Free Energy Landscape Perturbation for Estimating Mutation-Induced Population Shifts from Reference Molecular Dynamics Ensembles

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Abstract

Mutations can alter protein function by redistributing probability among conformational states, even when structural changes are modest. Directly estimating a perturbed conformational free energy landscape with molecular dynamics is expensive because each mutation requires a new converged simulation. Here, we introduce Free Energy Landscape Perturbation (FELP), a state-local reweighting framework that estimates mutation-induced population shifts from a reference ensemble. FELP partitions a reference trajectory into discrete microstates, evaluates restrained reference-to-perturbed energy differences for configurations sampled within each state, and combines spatially regularized state-local Zwanzig factors with the reference state probabilities to estimate the perturbed state distribution. FELP estimates how a perturbation changes the relative probabilities of conformational basins and reports effective-sample and overlap diagnostics that identify when the predicted shift lacks support in the sampled reference ensemble. We describe the FELP estimator, its implementation, and its performance on glycine dipeptide, chignolin, and T4 lysozyme. FELP is intended for perturbations that reshape populations within a sufficiently sampled reference landscape, providing a practical bridge between local alchemical energy evaluation and ensemble-level mechanistic interpretation.

1. Introduction

The functional repertoire of a protein is fundamentally determined by its conformational free energy landscape. Folding, stability, enzyme catalysis, signal transduction, molecular recognition, and allosteric regulation all depend on how probability is distributed over conformational states and how readily the system moves between them. Many proteins therefore function through ensembles of native-like substates, with activity controlled by changes in basin depth, transition pathways, and relative occupancy. Quantitatively describing these landscapes is central to understanding how sequence, ligand binding, protonation, and chemical modification alter biological function.

Molecular dynamics (MD) simulations provide a direct route to estimating these conformational free energy landscapes at atomistic resolution. In principle, sufficiently long trajectories recover both the relevant structural diversity and the thermodynamic probability of each state. In practice, sampling remains the cen-

tral limitation. Transitions between functional conformations can be slow, rare, and system-specific, such that converging a separate MD ensemble for every perturbation of interest is often prohibitively expensive. Parallel simulation strategies, enhanced sampling methods such as replica exchange[1] and metadynamics,[2] and Markov state models (MSMs)[3,4] have improved access to long-timescale behavior by combining many trajectories into kinetic and thermodynamic state models. However, even with these advances, each new mutation or chemical change can still demand substantial additional sampling to converge a new landscape. This expense is a principal bottleneck for systematic structure–function studies that require evaluating many perturbations against a shared conformational baseline.

To avoid the cost of full ensemble resampling, computational methods often sacrifice conformational diversity for speed. Single-structure and local relaxation methods, such as Rosetta $\Delta\Delta G$ estimates for mutation stability calculations, can test whether a particular coordinate set becomes more or less favorable after mutation, but they typically evaluate a narrow structural hypothesis.[5] Minimal relaxation avoids the cost of full resampling, yet it can convert small coordinate differences into abrupt energy changes and noisy estimates. These calculations can be useful for local stability screening, but they generally do not directly answer whether a mutation stabilizes one conformational basin over another.

Alchemical methods such as free energy perturbation (FEP) provide a formally rigorous extension of this idea. By computing free energy differences between Hamiltonians from local equilibrium samples, FEP incorporates local flexibility and avoids the abrupt energy changes of single-structure minimization.[6–11] However, practical protein mutation calculations remain structurally restricted because they are initialized from a small number of conformations and restrained to prevent structural drift. Both single-structure screening and local FEP calculations estimate the energetic effect of a perturbation in a specific structural context. Additional ensemble analysis is required to describe how that perturbation redistributes probability across a complex conformational landscape. Furthermore, exponential free energy estimators rely heavily on the assumption that the reference and target states share sufficient phase-space overlap.[12,13] Because these estimators are highly sensitive to rare and high-weight samples, inadequate overlap can produce unstable estimates that appear numerically converged but remain physically unsupported.

Recent population-shift strategies address this ensemble problem by separating conformational sampling from perturbation evaluation. This approach originally emerged in the context of ligand binding to quantify conformational selection and induced-fit mechanisms. Implicit-ligand theory, for example, provides a rigorous analytical framework for estimating how a binding event reweights host conformations without requiring explicit simulation of the bound complex.[14–17] While traditional implicit-ligand theory typically evaluates these shifts using exact volume integrals or analytical interaction potentials over a continuous ensemble, recent methods adapt this logic to discrete kinetic models and empirical scoring. PopShift, for instance, evaluates discrete ligand docking scores against the states of a ligand-free MSM to predict binding-induced population shifts.[18] The unifying insight of these approaches is that expensive sampling can be performed once for a reference system. Once the reference state probabilities are established, the effects of many different ligands can be evaluated against the same conformational baseline. This framework moves beyond single-structure scoring by explicitly linking the energetic preference of a perturbation to the thermodynamic weight of each conformational state.

Here, we introduce Free Energy Landscape Perturbation (FELP) to apply this population-shift framework to amino acid mutations. FELP combines a sampled reference ensemble, discrete state models, restrained local perturbation evaluation, and FEP-style reweighting. The method partitions a reference ensemble into discrete microstates, evaluates the energetic effect of a mutation within each state, and reweights the reference probabilities to estimate how the mutation redistributes probability over the pre-sampled landscape. By treating a global population shift

as a collection of tractable local reweighting problems, FELP bridges the gap between single-structure scoring and full-ensemble resampling. To address the inherent phase-space overlap limitations of exponential estimators, FELP explicitly audits its predictions using effective sample size and weight-concentration diagnostics.[19,20] These diagnostics ensure that the method not only predicts how a mutation reshapes a landscape but also identifies when a proposed perturbation falls outside the regime supported by the reference ensemble.

2. Theory

Consider a reference system with potential energy $U_0(x)$ and a perturbed system with potential energy $U_1(x)$, where x denotes a molecular configuration and $\beta = (k_B T)^{-1}$. The Boltzmann distribution maps these potential energy functions to continuous probability densities over configurations. FELP starts from a sampled reference ensemble, such as an MD trajectory or another state model with a meaningful reference prior, that represents configurations drawn from the reference distribution $p_0(x) \propto \exp[-\beta U_0(x)]$. FELP partitions this configuration space into discrete microstates $i \in \{1, \ldots, N\}$ using a chosen collective variable or feature representation. Let $\chi_i(x)$ be the indicator function for state i. The restricted partition function for state i under Hamiltonian a is

$$Z_a(i) = \int \chi_i(x) \exp[-\beta U_a(x)]\, dx, \qquad (1)$$

and the corresponding thermodynamic probability of the microstate is $\pi_a(i) = Z_a(i)/\sum_k Z_a(k)$. For the reference system, this is equivalent to integrating the continuous reference density over the microstate to obtain the reference prior $\pi_0(i)$. FELP aims to estimate the perturbed microstate probabilities $\pi_1(i)$ using only samples drawn from the reference ensemble **(Figure 1)**.

To bridge the reference and perturbed ensembles, FELP relies on the principle that global conformational shifts can be decomposed into local reweighting problems. Within a specific microstate, the ratio of restricted partition functions follows the two-state Zwanzig identity,

$$\frac{Z_1(i)}{Z_0(i)} = \langle \exp[-\beta \Delta U(x)] \rangle_{0,i}\,, \qquad (2)$$

where $\Delta U(x) = U_1(x) - U_0(x)$ and $\langle \cdot \rangle_{0,i}$ denotes an ensemble average over reference configurations conditioned on membership in state i. Normalizing the restricted partition functions over all microstates yields the central FELP estimator:

$$\pi_1(i) = \frac{\pi_0(i)\, \langle \exp[-\beta \Delta U(x)] \rangle_{0,i}}{\sum_k \pi_0(k)\, \langle \exp[-\beta \Delta U(x)] \rangle_{0,k}}. \qquad (3)$$

Equation 3 preserves the reference state decomposition and updates the probability of each state according to the perturbation's energetic effect on configurations sampled within that specific state.

The central hypothesis behind this formulation is that discretization creates domains of local phase-space overlap. By conditioning the exponential average on microstate membership, FELP assumes that reference configurations assigned to state i adequately represent the structural ensemble of the perturbed system within that same state. FELP evaluates the perturbation directly from the reference ensemble without simulating the target state or intermediate alchemical windows. If a mutation is unfavorable in one conformational basin but favorable in another, the state-local reweighting factors will predict a population shift between those basins.

In a finite trajectory, state i contains evaluated configurations x_{ij} for $j = 1, \ldots, n_i$. FELP estimates the local Zwanzig factor by computing

$$f_i = \frac{1}{n_i} \sum_{j=1}^{n_i} w_{ij}, \qquad w_{ij} = \exp[-\beta(\Delta U_{ij} - s)], \qquad (4)$$

where $s = \min(\Delta U)$ over all frames included in reweighting is a uniform stability shift that prevents numerical overflow. Because this shift is applied globally, it cancels during normalization. The sample estimator of eq 3 substitutes the empirical reference prior $\hat{\pi}_0(i)$ and the finite-sample

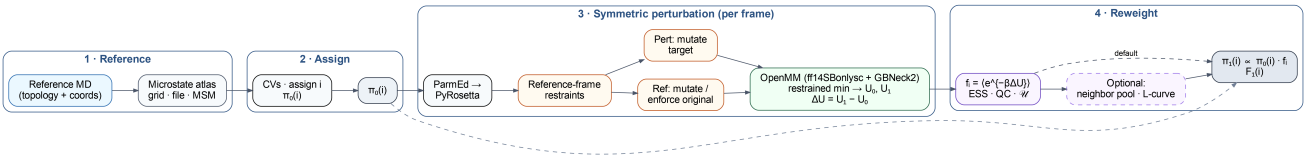


Figure 1. Free Energy Landscape Perturbation workflow. FELP begins from a sampled reference ensemble and a microstate atlas, assigns configurations to obtain the reference prior $\hat{\pi}_0(i)$, and evaluates symmetric reference and perturbed branches under reference-frame restraints. The default OpenMM reweighting Hamiltonian uses ff14SB-only side-chain parameters with GBNeck2 implicit solvent to compute $\Delta U = U_1 - U_0$ for each evaluated configuration. State-local Zwanzig factors are combined with $\hat{\pi}_0(i)$ to estimate $\hat{\pi}_1(i)$ and $F_1(i)$; optional neighbor pooling can regularize noisy local estimates before normalization.

factor f_i for their theoretical counterparts:

$$\hat{\pi}_1(i) = \frac{\hat{\pi}_0(i) f_i}{\sum_k \hat{\pi}_0(k) f_k}. \tag{5}$$

The corresponding relative free energy of each state is

$$F_1(i) = -k_B T \ln \hat{\pi}_1(i) + C, \tag{6}$$

where C is chosen so that the lowest finite state free energy is set to zero.

Now, for finite samples, f_i can be dominated by a small number of high-weight frames even when n_i is large. The local effective sample size,

$$\mathrm{ESS}_i = \frac{\left(\sum_j w_{ij}\right)^2}{\sum_j w_{ij}^2}, \tag{7}$$

quantifies this weight degeneracy.[21,22] Low ESS_i indicates that the local Zwanzig factor depends on too few configurations to be reliable.

Configuration space overlap requirements in unidirectional reweighting are fundamentally asymmetric. The reference ensemble must encompass the relevant configurations of the target ensemble, but the reverse is not true. It is expected that a broad reference trajectory will explore conformational states that become energetically forbidden or highly unfavorable upon perturbation. In these states, the local perturbation factor may have poor statistical support (low ESS_i), but this lack of support is inconsequential if the target probability $\hat{\pi}_1(i)$ in those states is vanishingly small. The reweighted landscape remains credible as long as the states that actually carry significant target probability are well-supported by the reference samples. However, because it is rarely known *a priori* whether the reference trajectory is sufficiently broad to cover all energetically relevant regions of the target ensemble, it is critical to explicitly quantify when the estimate relies on unsupported configurations. FELP therefore summarizes the validity of the reweighting operation by measuring the target probability mass assigned to unreliable states,

$$\mathcal{U} = \sum_i \hat{\pi}_1(i)\, \mathbf{1}\{\mathrm{ESS}_i < \epsilon_i\}, \tag{8}$$

where ϵ_i is an effective-sample floor for state i. Small $\mathcal{U}$ means the predicted landscape rests on states with adequate local support; large $\mathcal{U}$ is a direct reason for caution.

A separate practical issue arises from discretization. The potential energy functions U_0 and U_1 are continuous, so the true restricted partition functions of neighboring microstates should vary smoothly within a basin. Treating every microstate independently forces states with low ESS_i to produce local factors that fluctuate sharply relative to their neighbors. FELP can optionally regularize these estimates by pooling information across adjacent states in the feature-space topology. For state i, the pooled factor over supported neighbors $\mathcal{N}(i)$ is

$$\bar{f}_i = \frac{\sum_{j\in\mathcal{N}(i)} \mathrm{ESS}_j\, f_j}{\sum_{j\in\mathcal{N}(i)} \mathrm{ESS}_j}, \tag{9}$$

with $\bar{f}_i = f_i$ when no supported neighbors are available. The blended factor used for reweighting is

$$f_i^{\text{blend}} = \alpha_i f_i + (1-\alpha_i)\bar{f}_i, \qquad \alpha_i = \frac{\text{ESS}_i}{\text{ESS}_i + \tau}. \tag{10}$$

States with high ESS_i retain their local factors ($\alpha_i \approx 1$); states with low ESS_i borrow strength from well-supported neighbors. eq 5 can be evaluated with f_i^{blend} in place of the raw f_i. The blending rule is therefore a shrinkage estimator wherein ESS_i determines how strongly the state-local estimate is trusted, while τ sets the effective-sample scale at which neighborhood information is discounted. This preserves well-supported local perturbation factors while damping isolated fluctuations in poorly supported states.

When τ is not specified, FELP selects it by an L-curve criterion,[23] balancing fidelity to the state-local estimates against smoothness over neighboring states. The fidelity term is evaluated in log-factor space,

$$\mathcal{M}(\tau) = \sum_i \text{ESS}_i \left[\ln f_i - \ln f_i^{\text{blend}}(\tau)\right]^2, \tag{11}$$

so that well-supported states anchor the fit and deviations are measured on the scale of local free energy corrections. The corresponding graph-smoothness penalty is

$$\mathcal{R}(\tau) = \frac{1}{2}\sum_i \sum_{j\in\mathcal{N}(i)} \left[\ln f_i^{\text{blend}}(\tau) - \ln f_j^{\text{blend}}(\tau)\right]^2. \tag{12}$$

The selected τ is the corner of the $\mathcal{M}$–$\mathcal{R}$ curve in log–log space, defined as the point farthest from the chord connecting the two extremes. Importantly, while this regularization stabilizes noisy local factors on a discretized landscape, it does not compensate for missing reference support; $\mathcal{U}$ remains the primary validity criterion.

3. Results

3.1. Glycine dipeptide

Glycine dipeptide provides a minimal test of FELP in a well-understood two-dimensional conformational landscape. We projected the reference glycine MD ensemble into backbone Ramachandran (ϕ/ψ) space and partitioned it into uniform microstates for reweighting **(Figure 2A)**.

As a control, we first applied FELP to the self-perturbation GLY→GLY, where $\Delta U_{ij} = 0$ for every frame **(Figure 2B–D)**. Because $\exp(-\beta\cdot 0) = 1$, every state-local Zwanzig factor $f_i = 1$, and eq 5 returns $\hat{\pi}_1 = \hat{\pi}_0$ identically. The Kullback–Leibler (KL) divergence between the FELP-reweighted and MD distributions is essentially zero everywhere **(Figure 2D)**.

We next evaluated the dipeptide GLY→ALA perturbation. Glycine, lacking a side chain, samples the broadest Ramachandran landscape of the canonical amino acids. Alanine's methyl group restricts the accessible ϕ/ψ space, so we expect *a priori* that the alanine landscape is largely contained within the sampled glycine surface. Under these conditions, the asymmetric overlap requirement described above is satisfied, and FELP should recover the dominant population redistribution through reweighting. The FELP-reweighted alanine landscape reproduces the major minima observed in the independently sampled alanine MD simulation, correctly depopulating the positive-ϕ regions that are accessible to glycine but disfavored for alanine, while preserving the α_R and β basins **(Figure 2E–G)**. KL divergence values remain small across the landscape, predominantly reflecting modest differences in basin depths rather than missing conformational states.

A more demanding test is GLY→PRO. Proline's pyrrolidine ring constrains ϕ near $-60°$ and restricts ψ, producing a landscape substantially narrower than glycine's. The FELP-reweighted proline landscape correctly concentrates probability into the expected region and eliminates most of the broad glycine support **(Figure 2H–J)**. KL divergence is larger than for GLY→ALA, consistent with the greater mag-

nitude of the perturbation, but the dominant basins are recovered. Most remaining discrepancies between the FELP and MD proline landscapes are differences in the relative depths of existing minima rather than the presence or absence of conformational states.

These dipeptide benchmarks also expose the distinction between phase-space support and energetic agreement. Reference MD simulations used explicit-solvent ff19SB/OPC, whereas FELP evaluates ΔU with implicit-solvent ff14SBonlysc/GBNeck2. The reweighted landscapes therefore reflect both the statistical reweighting and the force field mismatch. Despite these differences, the overall agreement indicates that for perturbations that restrict the landscape, FELP recovers the correct topology of the target FEL.

The reverse transformation illustrates the expected failure mode. When alanine is used as the reference, the ALA→GLY perturbation must recover conformational basins in positive-ϕ Ramachandran space that the reference trajectory never sampled **(Figure 3B–D)**. FELP cannot create support where none exists. Accordingly, the reweighted landscape retains the topology of the alanine reference and fails to populate the broad glycine basins. By contrast, ALA→ALA returns the identity **(Figure 3E–G)**, and ALA→PRO succeeds because the proline landscape is a subset of the alanine support **(Figure 3H–J)**.

3.2. Overlap diagnostics quantify when reweighting fails

We next asked whether the failures illustrated in **Figures 2 and 3** could be identified directly from the reweighting statistics without access to an independent target MD simulation. We computed two diagnostics across all 20 canonical amino acid perturbations from GLY, ALA, and PRO reference ensembles **(Figure 4)**.

The first diagnostic is the target probability mass assigned to states with $\mathrm{ESS}_i < 10$ (eq 8; **Figure 4A**). From the glycine reference, this quantity remains below ∼0.15 for all targets, consistent with glycine's broad support. From the alanine reference, most targets are similarly well-supported, but ALA→GLY assigns nearly all of the target probability to low-ESS states ($\mathcal{U} \approx 1.0$), correctly flagging the failure observed in **(Figure 3B–D)**. From the proline reference, $\mathcal{U}$ is elevated (∼0.3–0.95) for the majority of targets, reflecting proline's constrained Ramachandran landscape and the correspondingly poor overlap with broader target ensembles.

The second diagnostic is the maximum normalized frame weight within each perturbation **(Figure 4B)**. From the glycine reference, maximum weights remain in the 10^{-4}–10^{-3} range, indicating that no single frame dominates the reweighting. From the alanine reference, maximum weights are comparably low for most targets but spike for ALA→GLY, where a small number of frames in the tails of the alanine ensemble disproportionately control the reweighted landscape. From the proline reference, maximum weights approach unity for several targets, indicating single-frame dominance.

These trends confirm the expected relationship between reference phase-space coverage and reweighting reliability: as the reference becomes more conformationally restricted, $\mathcal{U}$ increases and the reweighted landscape becomes dominated by rare, high-weight frames. Importantly, both diagnostics are computable without a target MD simulation and can be used prospectively to assess when a FELP prediction is physically supported.

3.3. Chignolin

To test FELP on a system where conformational preferences depend on coordinated intramolecular contacts rather than local backbone geometry, we applied FELP to the 10-residue miniprotein chignolin. We defined two collective variables based on Cα distances: Cα_1–Cα_{10} (termini proximity) and Cα_3–Cα_6 (turn formation). These coordinates distinguish folded, partially folded, and extended conformations.

We first evaluated the ability of FELP to predict the wild-type landscape from a CLN025 reference. CLN025 is a stabilized variant of chignolin with two mutations (G1Y, G10Y) that enhance the folding equilibrium. We therefore expect CLN025 to sample both folded and par-

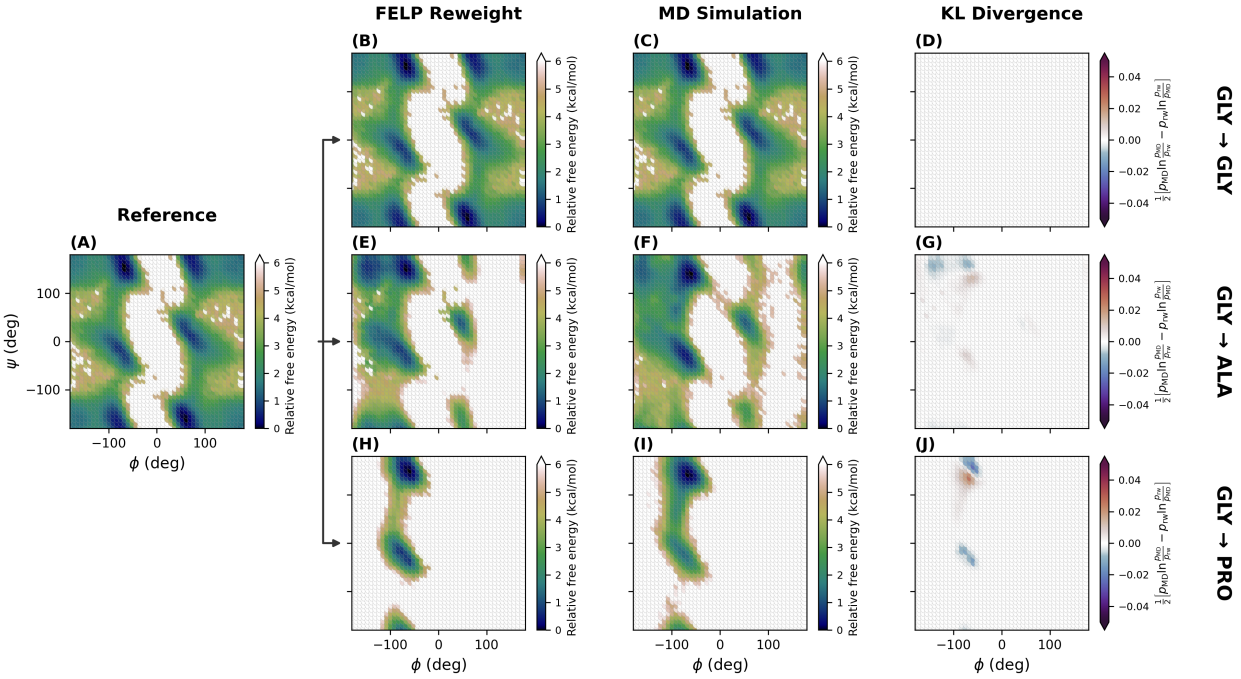


Figure 2. FELP reweighting from a glycine dipeptide reference. (A) Reference MD free energy landscape in ϕ/ψ space. For GLY→GLY (B–D), GLY→ALA (E–G), and GLY→PRO (H–J): FELP-reweighted landscape (left), independently sampled MD landscape (center), and KL divergence (right).

tially extended states, providing reference support for the less stable wild-type landscape. The MD wild-type landscape shows a broad distribution with population in both the folded basin (short Cα_1–Cα_{10} and Cα_3–Cα_6 distances) and an extended region at longer termini distances **(Figure 5A)**. The MD CLN025 landscape is more concentrated in the folded basin **(Figure 5B)**. The CLN025→WT FELP landscape recovers the folded basin and predicts some population redistribution toward extended states, though the extended region is sparser than in the MD wild-type landscape **(Figure 5C)**.

We also performed the reverse perturbation, WT→CLN025, where the wild-type reference provides broader support. FELP correctly concentrates probability into the folded basin relative to the reference **(Figure 5D)**, consistent with the experimentally observed stabilization of CLN025.

To quantify these predictions, we estimated folding free energies ΔG_{fold} by defining the folded state as the region with Cα_1–Cα_{10} < 8 Å and Cα_3–Cα_6 < 7 Å (dashed boxes in **Figure 5A–D**). Experimentally, both variants are marginally stable, with CLN025 more stable than wild-type by $\Delta\Delta G_{\text{fold}} \approx -1.0$ kcal mol^{-1} **(Figure 5E, F)**. The MD simulations yield $\Delta\Delta G_{\text{fold}}$ values consistent with experiment. FELP correctly predicts the sign of the stabilization but overestimates the magnitude of $\Delta\Delta G_{\text{fold}}$ by approximately 1.5 kcal mol^{-1} **(Figure 5F)**. This overestimation may reflect the implicit/explicit solvent mismatch, which becomes more consequential in a system where solvation contributes directly to folding thermodynamics. Nevertheless, the qualitative prediction that CLN025 is more stable than wild-type is recovered from the reweighting statistics alone.

3.4. T4 lysozyme

T4 lysozyme provides a test of FELP on a full-sized protein (164 residues) where the mutation of interest alters the conformational landscape through changes in hydrophobic core packing. The L99A substitution creates an internal cavity of approximately 150 Å^3 and is among the most extensively characterized cavity-creating mutations in structural biology, with

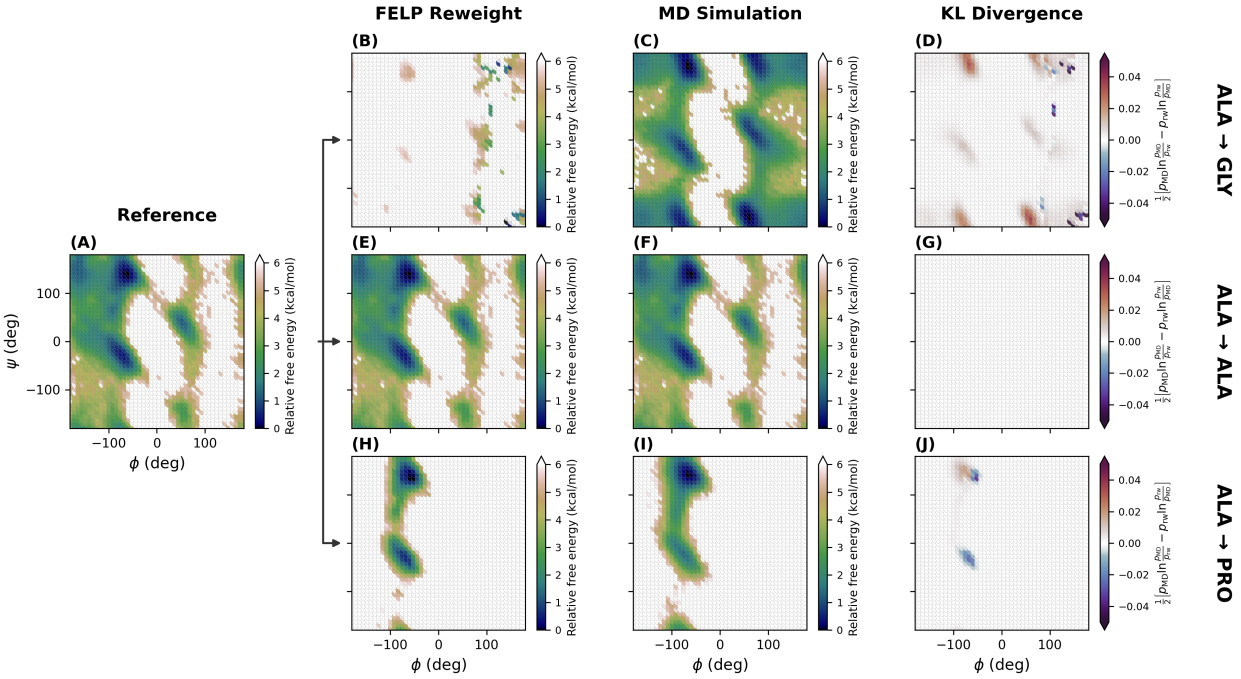


Figure 3. FELP reweighting from an alanine dipeptide reference. Layout as in Figure 2. ALA→GLY (B–D) fails to recover the broad glycine landscape absent from the reference support. ALA→ALA (E–G) returns the identity. ALA→PRO (H–J) succeeds because the proline landscape is contained within the alanine support.

well-documented effects on conformational exchange between ground and excited states observed by NMR relaxation dispersion and crystallography.[24,25] We used the L99A mutant as the reference ensemble and applied FELP to predict the wild-type (A99L) landscape, projecting onto ψ_{114}, the backbone dihedral angle of Phe114, which reports on helix F dynamics coupled to the cavity region.

The L99A reference ensemble is sharply unimodal, with nearly all probability concentrated in a single basin near $\psi_{114} \approx 55°$ **(Figure 6A)**. FELP predicts that restoring the leucine side chain redistributes this unimodal distribution into a multimodal landscape **(Figure 6B)**. The dominant basin near $\psi_{114} \approx 55°$ is retained but substantially depopulated, and a second basin emerges near $\psi_{114} \approx -55°$. Minor population appears near the periodic boundaries ($\psi_{114} \approx \pm 180°$). The corresponding free energy projection **(Figure 6C)** quantifies this redistribution: the L99A landscape confines the system to a single deep well with barriers exceeding 6 kcal mol^{-1} to alternative conformations, whereas the FELP-reweighted wild-type landscape has two accessible minima separated by an approximately 3 kcal mol^{-1} barrier, with the secondary basin near $\psi_{114} \approx -55°$ lying roughly 1.5 kcal mol^{-1} above the global minimum.

The prediction that restoring the leucine side chain broadens the accessible ψ_{114} landscape is physically intuitive: the larger side chain fills the L99A cavity and alters packing interactions in the hydrophobic core, changing the relative stability of helix F backbone conformations. Notably, this perturbation uses the conformationally restricted mutant as the reference. The dipeptide benchmarks established that reweighting from a restricted reference to a broader target is the more demanding direction, because the reference must provide sufficient phase-space support in regions where the target concentrates probability. Here, the reference MD employed an iterative seeding strategy that monitored ψ_{114} coverage and launched additional production runs from frames in under-sampled regions (see **Methods**), ensuring that the L99A trajectory sampled rare excursions outside the dominant basin. Without this enhanced reference coverage, the minor-basin populations in the

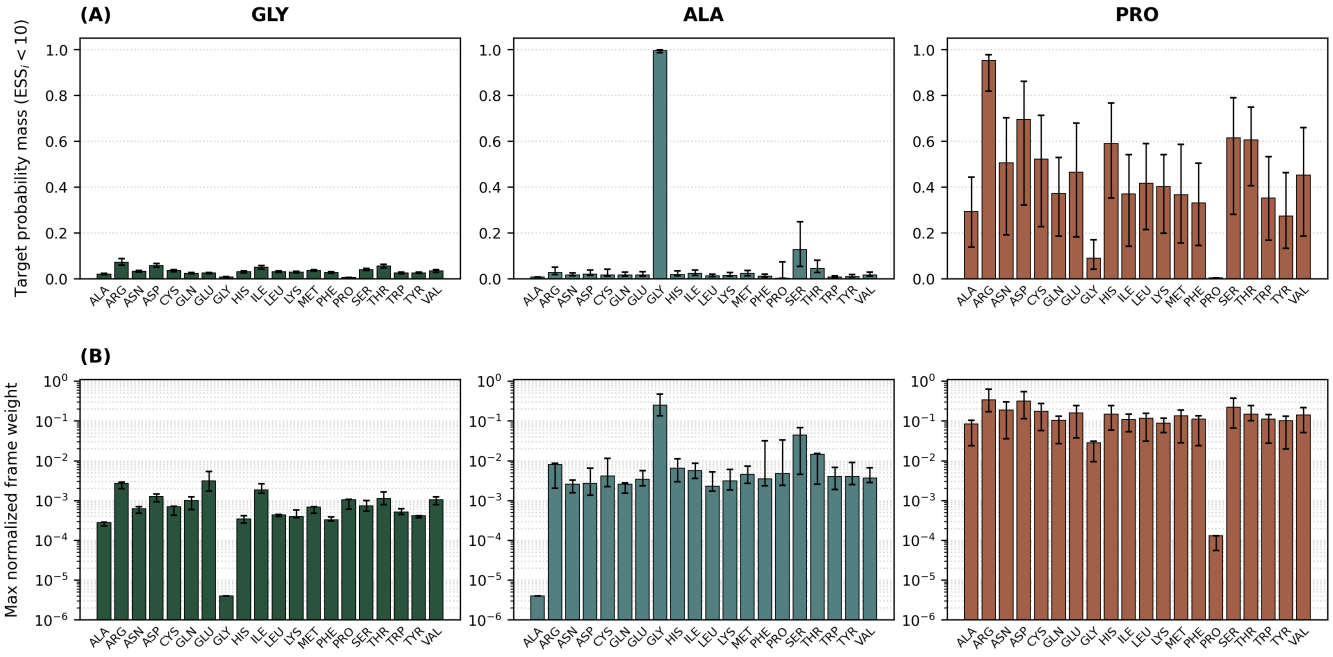


Figure 4. Overlap diagnostics across reference ensembles. (A) Fraction of target probability mass assigned to low-ESS (< 10) states ($\mathcal{U}$, eq 8) for all canonical amino acid targets from GLY, ALA, and PRO references. (B) Maximum normalized frame weight across the same perturbations. Error bars indicate bootstrap uncertainty across resampled evaluated frames.

reweighted landscape would rest on inadequate statistical support.

4. Discussion

Understanding how mutations alter conformational free energy landscapes is central to interpreting allosteric mechanisms, predicting resistance phenotypes, and guiding protein engineering. However, converging a separate MD ensemble for every mutation of interest is prohibitively expensive. FELP addresses this by asking a narrower question: given a well-sampled reference landscape, how does a chemical perturbation redistribute probability among the states already observed?

This reweighting strategy has precedent in the conformational selection literature. Abella et al. applied an analogous approach to evaluate peptide mutations from a wild-type Markov state model, reweighting metastable macrostate populations to predict binding shifts.[26] PopShift reweights MSM states using empirical docking scores to predict ligand-induced population shifts.[18] FELP generalizes these ideas by combining FEP-style energy evaluation with microstate-resolved reweighting and explicit overlap diagnostics.

Our dipeptide benchmarks demonstrate that FELP reliably recovers the perturbed landscape when the target conformational ensemble is contained within the reference support **(Figures 2, 3)**. The self-perturbation controls confirm that the pipeline introduces no numerical artifacts, and the GLY→ALA and GLY→PRO results show that FELP can correctly predict the restriction of accessible Ramachandran space upon side-chain addition. The reverse transformation, ALA→GLY, fails precisely because the target requires conformational basins absent from the reference ensemble. This failure is expected from the asymmetric overlap requirements of unidirectional reweighting and is correctly identified by the $\mathcal{U}$ diagnostic without access to a target simulation **(Figure 4)**. The chignolin benchmark extends these results to a system where the conformational equilibrium depends on coordinated intramolecular contacts. FELP correctly predicts the sign of the folding stabilization conferred by the CLN025 muta-

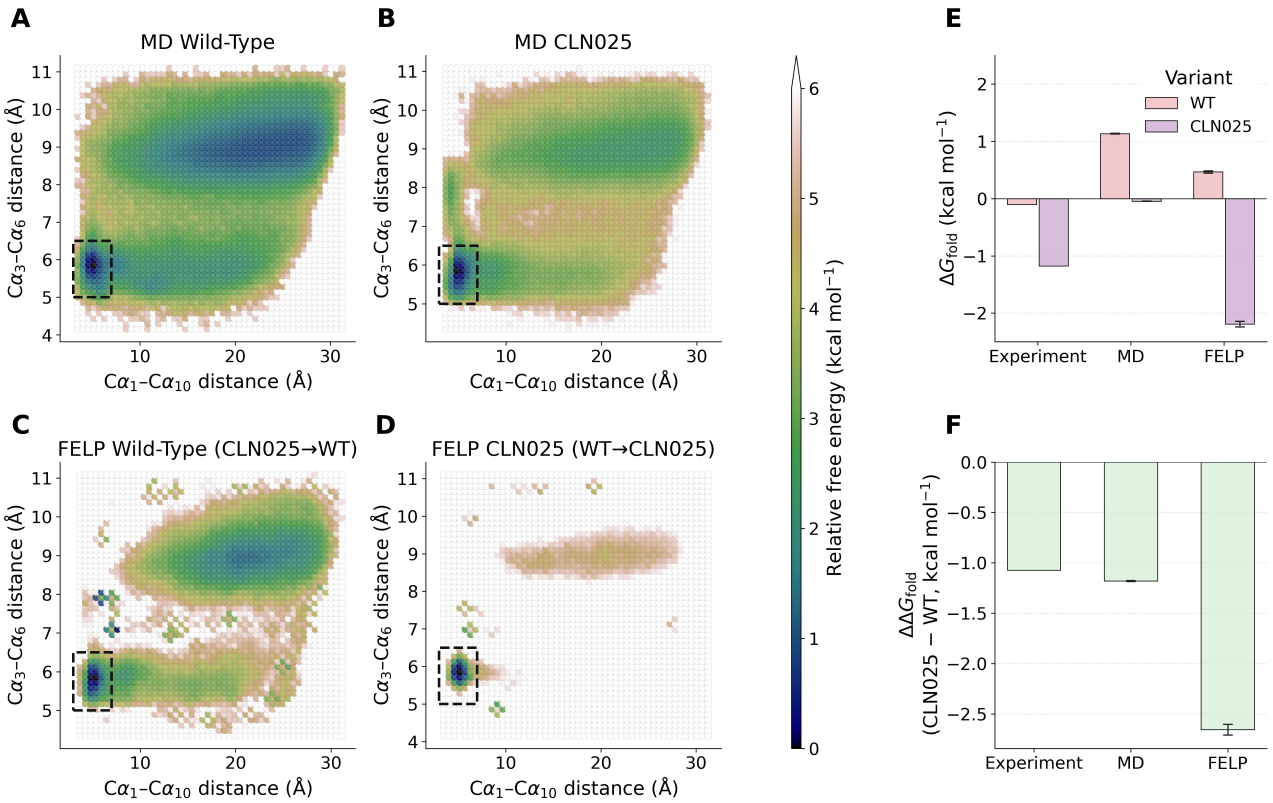


Figure 5. FELP predicts mutation-induced folding shifts in chignolin. (A, B) MD free energy landscapes for wild-type chignolin and CLN025 projected onto Cα_1–Cα_{10} and Cα_3–Cα_6 distances. Dashed boxes indicate the folded basin. (C) FELP CLN025→WT reweighted landscape. (D) FELP WT→CLN025 reweighted landscape. (E) Folding free energies ΔG_{fold} from experiment, MD, and FELP. (F) $\Delta\Delta G_{\text{fold}}$ (CLN025 − WT).

tions, though it overestimates the magnitude **(Figure 5F)**.

The local Zwanzig estimator is inherited from FEP and carries the same phase-space overlap requirements as any exponential reweighting calculation. The global landscape estimate is obtained by applying these local perturbation factors across a reference state model. Our diagnostics (ESS, maximum frame weight, $\mathcal{U}$) formalize this requirement as a computable criterion that accompanies every prediction. When diagnostics are favorable, FELP can estimate mutation-induced population shifts at far lower cost than independently converging each perturbed ensemble. When diagnostics are unfavorable, the method provides direct evidence that the reference ensemble does not adequately support the proposed perturbation and that new sampling is required.

The most important conceptual limitation is that FELP estimates the perturbed distribution over the reference state space. It cannot discover conformational basins that the reference trajectory did not visit. In the present implementation, energies are computed after local mutation and restrained relaxation without extended equilibration or explicit treatment of large-scale solvent reorganization. FELP is therefore best understood as an estimator of how a perturbation biases existing conformations, not as a substitute for free energy calculations in cases where the mutation induces substantial structural reorganization beyond the scope of the reference ensemble.

A related practical limitation arises from the solvent model mismatch. Reference MD simulations in our benchmarks were performed in explicit OPC water, whereas FELP evaluates ΔU using implicit GBNeck2 solvent on stripped protein coordinates. This choice avoids the need for explicit solvent relaxation at each evaluated frame, which would substantially increase com-

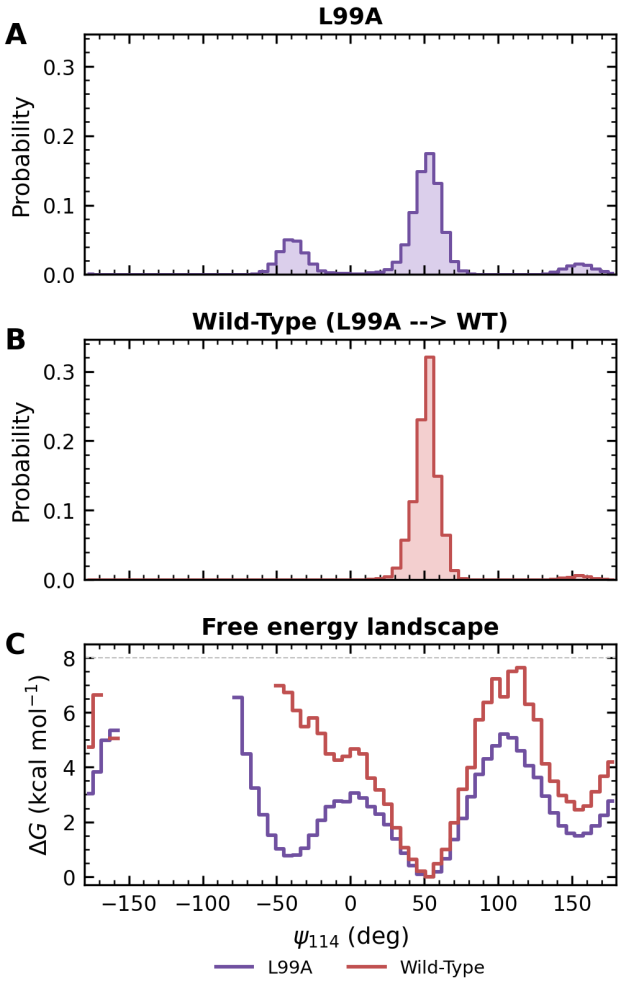


Figure 6. FELP predicts helix F conformational redistribution upon cavity filling in T4 lysozyme. (A) Reference L99A probability distribution over ψ_{114}. (B) FELP-reweighted wild-type (L99A→WT) distribution. (C) Free energy landscapes for L99A (purple) and FELP-reweighted wild-type (red).

putational cost and reduce the practical advantage of the reweighting approach. However, it introduces a systematic approximation: the ΔU values reflect the mutation's effect under implicit solvation rather than in the explicit-solvent environment of the reference trajectory. For small perturbations in well-packed protein cores, this mismatch may be modest; for perturbations that change solvent exposure or disrupt hydrogen-bonding networks, the implicit-solvent ΔU may diverge from the explicit-solvent value. The overestimation of $\Delta\Delta G_{\text{fold}}$ in chignolin **(Figure 5F)** is consistent with this limitation, as solvation effects contribute directly to the folding thermodynamics of a 10-residue miniprotein. For membrane proteins, this issue is compounded: evaluating stripped coordinates in bulk implicit solvent discards protein–lipid interactions, asymmetric electrostatics, and hydrophobic mismatch effects that were present in the explicit bilayer simulation.

These diagnostics make FELP useful as a screening tool for structural hypotheses about mutation-induced functional shifts. A predicted redistribution can be prioritized when it occurs on a functional free energy surface and carries low unreliable target probability mass; conversely, high $\mathcal{U}$ or concentrated frame weights provide direct evidence that the prediction should be treated as a sampling problem rather than as a mechanistic conclusion. Future development should address the solvent mismatch either through explicit-solvent evaluation protocols or through hybrid strategies that reintroduce solvent contributions selectively. Extending the benchmarks to larger proteins with experimentally characterized conformational equilibria will further clarify the practical scope of the reweighting approximation.

5. Methods

5.1. FELP workflow

The FELP workflow has four stages **(Figure 1)**. First, a sampled reference ensemble is obtained for the system expected to contain the relevant conformational ensemble. In the present benchmarks this ensemble comes from explicit solvent MD simulations, but in general the requirement is a meaningful prior over reference states. The sampled configurations are summarized into microstates defined in a chosen collective variable space, such as a uniform ϕ/ψ grid, distances or other user-specified coordinates in an explicit JSON/YAML state file, or states imported from an exported MSM bundle.

Second, each reference frame is assigned to a microstate. When raw-count priors are used, $\hat{\pi}_0(i)$ is the empirical fraction of assigned reference frames in state i. When a state file or MSM bundle contains trusted reference probabilities,

FELP can instead normalize those loaded priors. For the purposes of our benchmark systems in this study, we made use of raw counts from our MD simulations as our priors.

Third, FELP evaluates selected configurations within each state. The purpose of this stage is to estimate how a mutation changes the energy of each reference frame while keeping the comparison local to the microstate in which that frame was observed. For every frame, FELP prepares two branches from the same starting pose: the reference branch enforces the original residue identity, and the perturbed branch introduces the target amino acid(s). We measure the configured collective variables in the reference pose and convert those values into restraint targets. Strong harmonic restraints in the CV definition space are applied identically to both branches, so that each evaluated structure remains pinned to the assigned conformational coordinates while the mutation is introduced and scored.

Local structure preparation was performed with PyRosetta Cartesian FastRelax using the constrained ref2015 score function. Backbone-dihedral CVs are enforced as Rosetta dihedral constraints and distance CVs as atom-pair constraints with narrow harmonic widths. In addition to these CV restraints, FELP exposes separate controls over which internal degrees of freedom may relax. By default, FastRelax was run for five cycles with Cartesian minimization, rigid-body jumps disabled, and design disabled. Side-chain repacking is restricted to a mobile residue set selected by the mobility policy; all other side chains are held fixed through the task factory. Unless a benchmark specified otherwise, only the mutated residue side chain is mobile. These mobility settings determine how much additional relaxation is permitted around the pinned CV coordinates and therefore trade structural flexibility for computational cost; they do not replace the CV restraints themselves.

After Rosetta preparation, both branches are converted for evaluation in OpenMM with the ff14SB sidechain-only protein force field and GBNeck2 implicit solvent. The base CV restraints are re-imposed as harmonic torsion and distance potentials, atoms outside the mobile set are fixed by zero mass, and each structure is energy-minimized until convergence. FELP records the energy difference $\Delta U_{ij} = U_1(x_{ij}) - U_0(x_{ij})$ for each evaluated frame and excludes failed or non-finite frames from reweighting.

Fourth, FELP aggregates frame-level Boltzmann factors into state-level reweighting factors. Perturbed probabilities follow eq 5, with local factors f_i computed from the in-state average of $w_{ij} = \exp[-\beta(\Delta U_{ij} - s)]$. To regularize noisy local estimates before normalization, we applied neighbor pooling across cardinal directions on the assignment grid, with the blending strength τ selected by the L-curve criterion described in **Theory**.

Dipeptide FELP settings. Dipeptide mutations used residue 2 as the perturbation site and a 45×45 ϕ/ψ grid for assignment. The ϕ and ψ angles of residue 2 were restrained in both Rosetta and OpenMM using a force constant of 100,000. No distance restraints or extra Rosetta-only backbone restraints were used. The default target-only mobility policy was used, so only the target side chain was repacked and minimized.

Chignolin FELP settings. Chignolin CLN025→WT calculations mutated residues 1 and 10 simultaneously (Y1G/Y10G) and used automatic microstates built from two distance CVs: Cα_1–Cα_{10} and Cα_3–Cα_6. These distances were the base restraints in both stages. In Rosetta they were applied as atom-pair harmonic constraints with $\sigma = 0.001$ Å; in OpenMM they were applied as harmonic bond restraints with force constant 1,000,000. The Rosetta preparation stage also included Rosetta-only ϕ/ψ restraints on residues 1, 2, 9, and 10, using force constant 25,000 and a 15° tolerance for validation. Mobility used a sequence window of one residue around each mutation site with backbone and side-chain motion enabled, so residues 1–2 and 9–10 were mobile. An identical protocol was used for the WT→CLN025 (G1Y/G10Y) calculation.

T4 lysozyme FELP settings. T4 lysozyme A99L calculations used automatic microstates along ψ_{114}. The ψ_{114} dihedral was the base restraint in both Rosetta and OpenMM, with force constant 10,000 during Rosetta preparation and 1,000,000 during OpenMM minimization. Rosetta preparation also applied Rosetta-

only ϕ/ψ restraints to residue 99 with force constant 25,000 and a 15° validation tolerance. The mobile set was limited to the mutated residue, so only the residue 99 sidechain was mobile.

5.2. Reference simulations and trajectory processing

Molecular dynamics simulations. Except where specified otherwise below, reference ensembles were generated with explicit-solvent molecular dynamics using AMBER 24[27] and the GPU-accelerated `pmemd.cuda` engine. Proteins were parameterized with the ff19SB force field[28] and solvated in orthorhombic periodic boxes of OPC water.[29] Systems were neutralized with Na^+ or Cl^- counterions using the monovalent ion parameters of Joung and Cheatham.[30] Simulations used periodic boundary conditions, the particle mesh Ewald method for long-range electrostatics with a 12.0 Å real-space cutoff, and bond constraints on hydrogen-containing bonds.[31] Hydrogen mass repartitioning (HMR) was applied to non-solvent atoms with ParmEd. We sequentially minimized solvent, solute, and the full system with 500 steps of steepest-descent minimization followed by 2,000 steps of conjugate-gradient minimization in each stage. Systems were heated from 10 K to 100 K in the canonical (NVT) ensemble for 1.0 ns and then to 310 K in the isothermal–isobaric (NPT) ensemble at 1 bar using a Monte Carlo barostat and isotropic volume scaling over an additional 1.0 ns. These two stages of heating were repeated as needed until the system was stable at 1 bar and 310 K. Production used a Langevin thermostat with collision frequency $\gamma = 1.0$ ps^{-1} at 310 K and a 4.0 fs timestep. Trajectory snapshots were saved every 10 ps.

Dipeptides. Capped dipeptide structures (ACE–X–NME) were built with `tleap`. Each dipeptide was solvated with a 20 Å padding of OPC water. Production simulations of 2500 ns were performed for each dipeptide.

Chignolin. Initial structures for wild-type chignolin and CLN025 were built in an extended conformation from sequence using `tleap`. The wild-type sequence was specified as `NGLY TYR ASP PRO GLU THR GLY THR TRP CGLY`. CLN025 was built similarly using the corresponding G1Y/G10Y sequence. Each system was solvated with a 15 Å padding of OPC water. Reference trajectories were generated using the general MD protocol above. Production simulations of 5000 ns were performed for each system.

T4 lysozyme L99A. Five X-ray structures capturing diverse starting states of T4 L99A lysozyme (PDB IDs: 4W52, 4W53, 4W54, 4W57, 4W59) were obtained and prepared by extracting chain A, retaining the first model, resolving non-canonical modified residues, and removing experimental artifacts. Systems were prepared with `tleap` using 12 Å solvent padding. Production simulations were carried out for 5000 ns from each starting state.

5.3. Diagnostics and quality control

Before state-level factors f_i are computed, FELP applies optional by-state quality control to the in-state Boltzmann weights. For each microstate, in-state weights are built from ΔU_{ij}, and the upper-tail Pareto shape k of the weight distribution is estimated with a PSIS-style rule. A state is flagged when k exceeds a sample-size-dependent reliability threshold. When considering frames for exclusion, the flagged states enter an iterative loop, such that the highest-weight frame is removed, diagnostics are recomputed, and the loop continues until the state is no longer flagged or some maximum number of frames have been excluded (nominally, five by default). Local Zwanzig factors and ESS_i are then computed from the remaining frames only.

Validity is summarized using eq 8 and its implementation extension,

$$\mathcal{U} = \sum_i \hat{\pi}_1(i)\, \mathbf{1}\{\mathrm{ESS}_i < \epsilon_i \text{ or } q_i = 1\}, \quad (13)$$

where $\epsilon_i = \max(5,\, 0.1\, n_i)$ with n_i the number of evaluated frames in state i, and $q_i = 1$ when by-state diagnostics identify dominant-frame control of the local average (including states that remain flagged after frame exclusion). The run summary also records per-state ESS_i, maximum

normalized frame weights, and the target probability carried by QC-flagged states.

6. Code and Data Availability

The FELP source code and associated sample runtime scripts are freely available under an MIT license at `https://github.com/bpbrownlab/felp`.

7. Author Contributions

B.P.B. conceived the study. T.E.M. and B.P.B wrote the code, designed the experiments, performed the simulations, conducted the analyses, interpreted the results, and wrote the manuscript.

8. Disclosures

B.P.B is an advisor for Septagen Pharmaceuticals.

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